PROJECT PHASE I REPORT

On

Analysis and Verification of Wind Profile Estimation Algorithms

Submitted by

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in partial fulfilment of the requirements for the award of the degree of B.Tech in Electronics and Communication Engineering



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CERTIFICATE

Certified that the project report entitled ***"Analysis and Verification of Wind Profile Estimation Algorithms"*** *is a bonafide work of* ***Naveen C Lal (20323079), Roopesh O R (20323085), Sneha S (20323094)*** *towards the partial fulfilment of the award of the degree of B.Tech in Electronics and Communication of Cochin University of Science and Technology, Kochi-682022.*

Project Guide **Head of the Division**

Acknowledgment

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Abstract

Accurate wind profile estimation from wind profiler radar data is important for atmospheric studies and weather forecasting, yet it remains a challenging area due to low signal-to-noise ratio and other interferences. This project investigates and evaluates Doppler spectrum processing algorithms for the 205 MHz Stratosphere-Troposphere (ST) radar facility at the Cochin University of Science and Technology (CUSAT). Specifically, we analyse the Mutual Convolution Cost Function (MCCF) and Improved Moments Estimation (IME) algorithms, alongside hybrid approaches combining mutual convolution with IME pipelines.

To assess algorithmic performance without the limitations of conventional validation tools like radiosondes, a synthetic data test bench was developed by reversing the radar signal processing chain. Diverse raw data samples incorporating crude approximations of atmospheric wind phenomena, turbulence, and clutter were generated. The algorithms were evaluated using mean square error and Pearson's correlation coefficient. Simulation results demonstrate that the IME algorithm achieves superior accuracy and lower error rates compared to MCCF and other hybrid configurations.

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Chapter 1:
Introduction

The atmosphere is a chaotic dynamic system with many phenomena happening. For a long time, researchers have been trying to model the atmosphere for weather forecasting and climate modelling. Among them, the gradient of wind velocity is important. In the past, the wind velocity was measured using radiosonde, a balloon-borne instrument released once now and then, at a fixed location. Although radiosondes remain the reference standard, they provide sparse temporal sampling, drift away from the launch site as they ascend, and cannot offer a continuous view of evolving atmosphere. In this context, remote sensing by wind profile radar provides a powerful complement.

1.1 Wind profile radar

A wind profiler radar transmits electromagnetic pulses into the sky and picks up extremely weak echoes returned by minute fluctuations in the refractive index of air produced by turbulence and hydrometeors such as raindrops. Because these scatterers are carried by the wind, the Doppler shift of the returned signal can be used to estimate the velocity of the air along the radar beam. By pointing the beam in different directions, the 3D wind vector can be reconstructed at every range gate, giving a near-continuous record of the wind. The beams can be steered mechanically or electronically. This process is called Doppler Beam Swing (DBS).

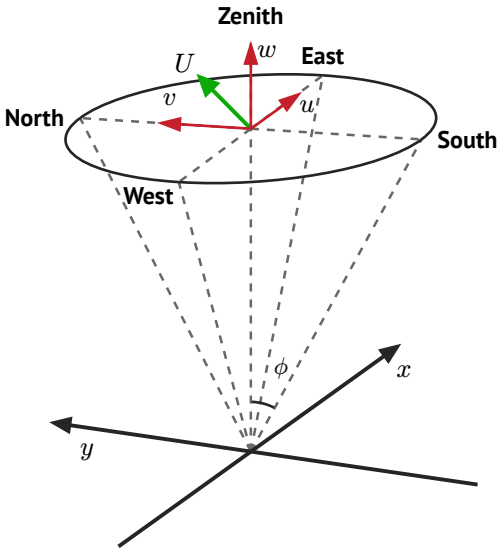


Figure 1.1: Doppler Beam Swing method

However, the quality of the record depends entirely on how reliably the wind velocity is estimated from the measured Doppler spectrum. In this report, we discuss few algorithms used in velocity estimation, as well as a test bench upon which algorithms can be further evaluated and developed. The main focus is on processing radar data obtained from

Stratosphere–Troposphere radar (ST Radar) the operating at the Cochin University of Science and Technology, Kochi.

1.2 The ST Radar Facility at CUSAT

The ST radar is located at the Advanced Centre for Atmospheric Radar Research (ACARR) on the university campus in Kochi. It was proposed to the Department of Science and Technology, Government of India, under its IRHPA scheme, with the specific aim of studying the characteristics and dynamics of the Indian summer monsoon at its gateway. Kerala is the point at which the south-west monsoon first makes landfall over the Indian subcontinent, and a continuously operating wind profiler at this location provides a unique vantage point on the onset, progress and intraseasonal variability of the monsoon circulation, as well as on other weather phenomena. The radar was designed, developed and installed indigenously, with the system fabricated by Data Patterns under the guidance of the university's scientists and engineers, and it became fully operational in December 2016. It is regarded as the first atmospheric wind profiler radar to operate successfully in the 205 MHz frequency band. The specifications of the radar are summarised in Table 1.1

Parameter	**Specification**
Frequency	205 MHz
Bandwidth	5 MHz
Type of system	Active Phased Array
Antenna element	Three Element Yagi-Uda
Height coverage	315 m to 20 km
Range gates	1024 (Programmable)
Modes	DBS/SAM
Height resolution	$\approx$ 45 m to 720m
Beam width	$\approx 3°$
Off Zenith Angle	$0°$ to $30°$ in steps of $1°$
Beam positions in Azimuth	$0°$ to $360°$ with $1°$ resolution
Pulse width	$0.3\mu s$ to $76.8\mu s$
Modulation	Binary Phase Shift Keying (BPSK)
Code	Complementary Code/Barker Code
Baud rate	$0.3\mu s$ to $4.8\mu s$ in steps of 0.3
PRF	100 Hz to 16 kHz Selectable
Peak Power	500 W (typical per element)
Duty ratio	Up to 15 % (Max)
Peak power aperture product	$\approx 1.6 \times 10^8$ (typical) Wm^2

Parameter	Specification
Radar system sensitivity	−165 dBm(post processing)
Dynamic range	70 dB(min)
Type of receiver	Direct band with sampling
Type of signal processor	FFT based frequency domain
Horizontal wind Velocity	Up to 70 ms^{-1}
Vertical wind velocity	Up to 30 ms^{-1}
Radial velocity resolution	Better than 0.1 ms^{-1}

Table 1.1: Specification of ST Radar from [1]

The radar has been validated using measurements from a radiosonde. The caliberation is performed using the radio source Virgo A and by tracking the Moon

1.3 Signal processing chain

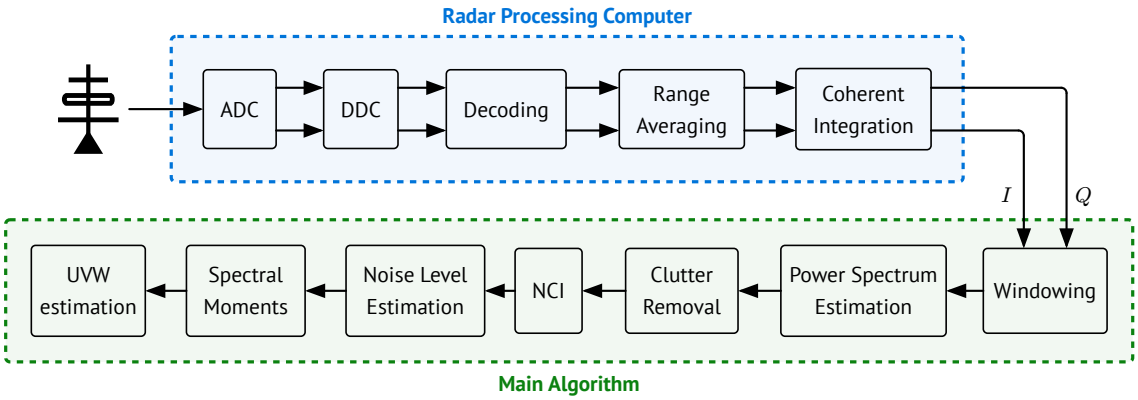


Figure 1.2: Signal processing chain

Complex In-phase and Quadrature (IQ) samples are collected for each range gate and beam direction; they are coherently integrated to improve the SNR. All these stages happen at the radar processing computer. Later, windowing is applied to reduce noise. Then the power spectrum is estimated via FFT; clutter algorithms are applied; Non-Coherent Integration (NCI) is applied; then the remaining noise level is estimated, which is useful in moment estimation. Finally, wind velocity in each beam direction and then UVW is computed.

1.4 Challenges in Wind Profiler Data Processing

Accurate wind estimation from wind profiler radar data is challenging because atmospheric echoes are generally weak and can be affected by noise, interference, and unwanted reflections. Signal strength often decreases with altitude, making the atmospheric echo difficult to distinguish from background noise. Under low signal-to-noise ratio (SNR)

conditions, identifying the correct Doppler peak becomes less reliable and may lead to inaccurate velocity estimates.

The received Doppler spectrum may also contain ground clutter, radio-frequency interference (RFI), and echoes from aircraft, birds, and insects. Ground clutter is generally concentrated around zero Doppler frequency and can mask atmospheric signals, while RFI and moving objects may introduce peaks that are unrelated to atmospheric motion. During rainfall, precipitation echoes can appear along with clear-air echoes, producing multiple peaks in the spectrum. Similarly, reflections from different atmospheric layers may result in overlapping spectral components.

These conditions make Doppler peak identification difficult, as the strongest peak does not always correspond to the actual atmospheric signal.In addition, wind profiler radars continuously generate large volumes of data across multiple beams and range gates. Therefore, the processing method must provide reliable estimates under varying atmospheric conditions while maintaining reasonable computational efficiency. Manual inspection of individual spectra is not practical for continuous operation, highlighting the need for robust and automated methods for Doppler spectrum processing and wind estimation.

1.5 Research motivation and problem definition

The challenges associated with Doppler spectrum processing highlight the need for reliable methods to identify atmospheric signals and estimate wind velocity accurately.

The main problem addressed in this work is the accurate identification of atmospheric Doppler peaks and estimation of their corresponding spectral moments from the radar observations. An incorrect peak selection can lead to errors in radial velocity estimation, which subsequently affect the retrieval of the three-dimensional wind components.

To address this problem, this project investigates the Improved Moments Estimation (IME) and Mutual Convolution Cost Function (MCCF) methods for Doppler spectrum processing. Their performance is evaluated using radar observations, with particular attention to peak identification accuracy. A hybrid approach combining the advantages of these methods is also tried to improve the reliability of wind estimation.

The overall aim is to develop and evaluate a suitable processing approach for the 205 MHz ST radar data that provides reliable Doppler spectral moments and wind profiles under different atmospheric conditions.

Chapter 2:
Estimation and Verification Methods

Various techniques for moment/peak estimations have been devised in the past decade. Some of them cover general cases while others are better suited for specific environments. In this chapter, we discuss a generic method and 2 established ones: MCCF and IME. We also discuss mixing IME and MCCF methods. In the 2nd part, we discuss some methods used to verify the accuracy of algorithms.

2.1 Estimation Methods

2.1.1 Mutual Convolution Cost Function (MCCF)

MCCF is a peak estimation algorithm proposed by Tang et al. [2] which uses Mutual convolution to improve SNR and a velocity-frequency-weighted cost function to estimate the most prominent peak in the spectrum. It also uses a space-time Doppler window (ST window) to limit the number of candidate peaks as well as to improve the continuity of the velocity profile. The space window is used to improve velocity continuity over height ranges, and the time window is used to improve velocity continuity in specific height over time.

The algorithm is illustrated in Figure 2.1. Here, the cylindrical entries are final data as well as intermediate data acquired. The intermediate data might be useful for other algorithms to work on in further processing steps.

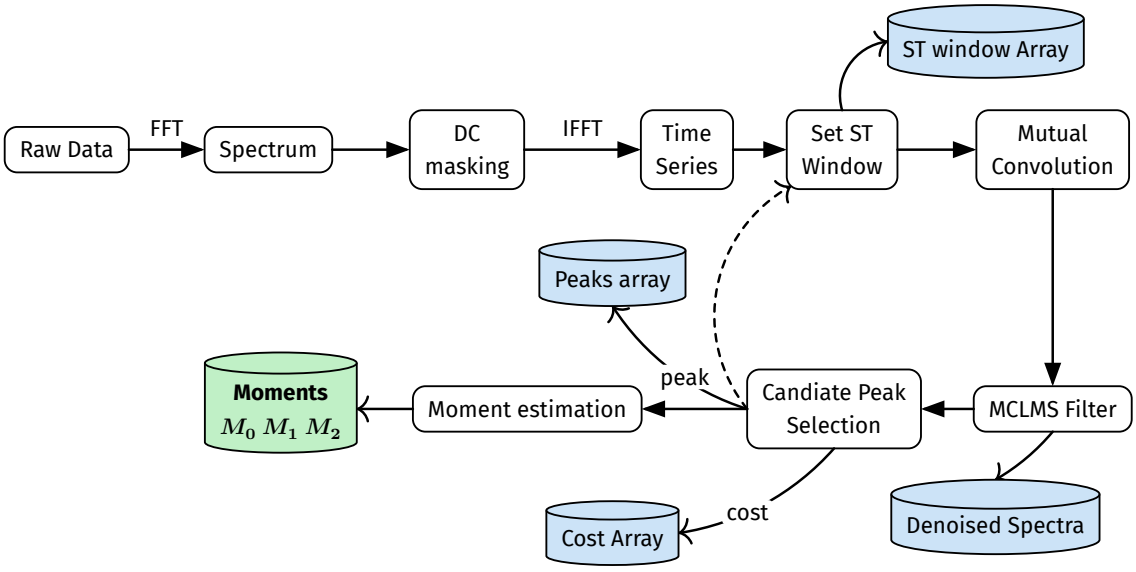


Figure 2.1: MCCF Algorithm Flow.

Individual steps are explained in upcoming subsections. The method applied to a doppler spectrum is shown in Figure 2.2

Preprocessing

Here the FFT of time series raw data (slow sampled) is computed. Then DC masking is applied in which value of 5 bins near DC bin is replaced with bacground noise with random phase. It is then converted back to time series data.

Setting the Space-Time Doppler Window

This step improves velocity profile continuity by limiting number of candidate peaks. By setting a doppler window in *space axis* peaks outside this window is rejected. This window accounts for maximum wind shear between height bins. Detting a doppler window in *time axis* applies the assumption that during a time interval wind velocity changes at some maximum rate. The Space-Time window is intersection of both windows.

Mutual Convolution

In this step the noise is heavily suppressed and SNR is improved. It works by slicing a spectrum in a height bin P into n slices of length $N/2$ (where N is length of original spectrum) then convolving adjacent slices ($X_i = V_i * V_{i+1}$) together to form $n-1$ results. From these results a optimal solution segment X_r is chosen which contain the highest peak among all results. Also the segment adjacent to X_r is chosen as suboptimal solution X'_r. Both of these are used in MCLMS filter.

MCLMS Adaptive Filtering

MCLMS (Modified Complex Least Mean Square) filter is a adaptive filter. It learns its weight during slicing of spectrums, and after modifying the weight vector final filtered spectra is obrained through the optimal and suboptimal spectras. MCLMS can suppress clutter clutter even more by training a model that tries to match optimal solution with suboptimal solution. In the end the spectrum will have some of the clutter suppressesd.

2.1.2 Candidate Peak Selection, Cost Function & Moment Estimation

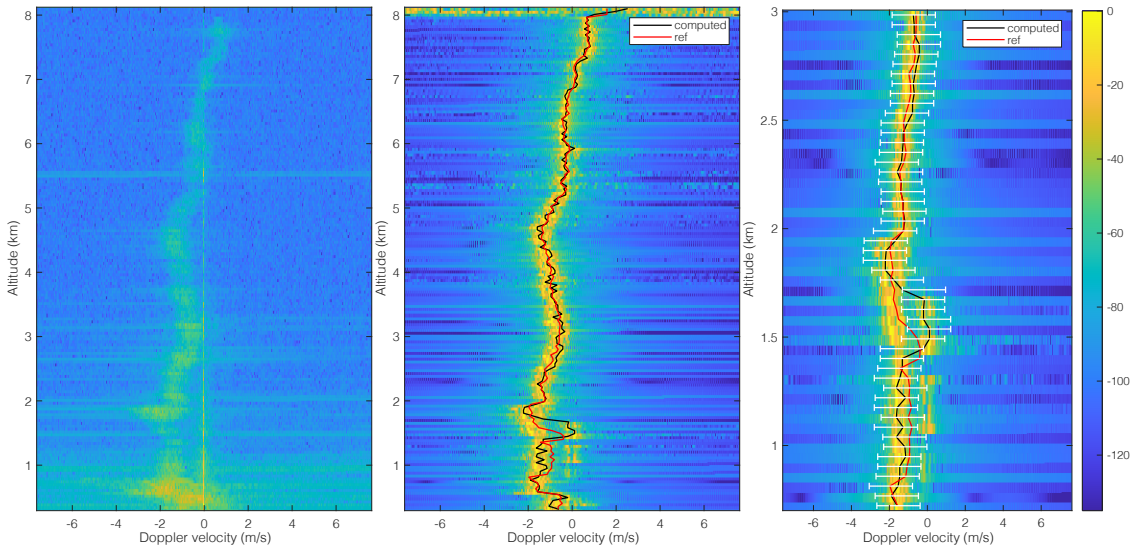
Peaks in ST doppler window which has amplitude $\geq 40\%$ of maximum peak are chosen as candidate peaks. The algorithm assigns a "cost" to each of these peaks based on their velocity difference between each frequency bin $V_{r+1,j}$ given by:

$$V_{r+1,j} = 1 - \left| (M_{r+1,j} - M_r) \frac{d_v}{\alpha V_d} \right|$$

and magnitude of peak itself $M_{r+1,j}$. Here d_v represents the velocity resolution, V_d represents the maximum wind shear, α is the window coefficient. The cost of each peak is given by:

$$F_{r+1,j} = w_1 V_{r+1,j} + w_2 M_{r+1,j}$$

The peaks with higest cost value is taken as the spectral peak. From this moments can be estimated based on Hildreth-Seikh method.



(a) (b) (c)

*Figure 2.2: Power spectrum (a) Original, (b) after applying DC removal, mutual convoluton and MCLMS, (c) Computed moments, reference moment and **Space window [white]** overlayed*

The peaks estimated from one height bin is used to set ST window in next height bin, hence the process is iterative and cannot be done in single matrix operation step as in computing spectrum.

2.1.3 Improved Moments Estimation (IME)

The Improved Moments Estimation (IME) algorithm proposed by Li **et al.**[3] is designed to extract reliable Doppler velocity profiles from ground-based K-band wind radar spectra, particularly when the atmospheric echoes have low SNR and are contaminated by clutter or multiple spectral peaks. The method combines the adaptive Doppler-window concept of the Adaptive Moments Estimation (AME) method with the cost-function-based profile tracing concept of the Multiparameter Cost Function (MPCF) method. Its main objective is to reduce the computational search space while maintaining reliable wind-profile detection under low-SNR conditions.

The IME procedure consists of three main stages:

1. Preprocessing of the Doppler power spectra
2. Adaptive Doppler-window selection and identification of prospective spectral peaks
3. Grouping, profile tracing, and cost allocation.

Data Preprocessing

Before profile extraction, the Doppler power spectra are processed to suppress unwanted spectral components. First, the zero-frequency region is affected by direct-current (DC) components and ground clutter. These components are suppressed by interpolation, in which the average values of three points around zero frequency are used to replace the contaminated values. Next, a five-point moving-average filter is applied

to suppress transient interference while preserving the atmospheric echo characteristics. Finally, the noise power density S_n of each range bin is estimated using the Hildebrand–Sekhon method. The estimated noise level is subtracted from the power spectrum, and negative values are set to zero. The resulting spectrum is therefore more suitable for identifying atmospheric spectral peaks. The preprocessing procedure described in the paper is summarized in Figure 2.3

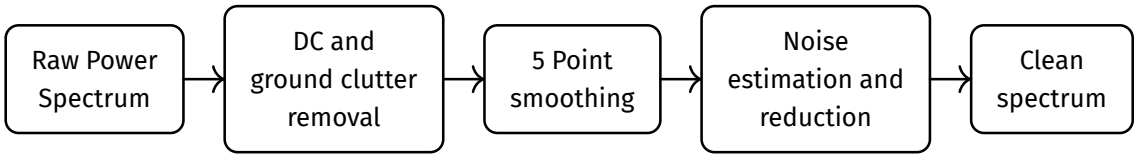


Figure 2.3: IME Method

These preprocessing operations help identify weak atmospheric echoes by reducing the effects of random noise, radio-frequency interferenc.,

Adaptive Doppler Window and Prospective Peak Selection

The IME algorithm starts at the lowest range bin and searches for candidate spectral peaks only within an adaptive Doppler window. For a selected spectral component, the algorithm determines the peak position and the left and right zero-crossing points, from which the radial velocity, spectral width, and SNR are calculated. A peak is retained as a prospective atmospheric component when its SNR is greater than 0 dB. Up to three prospective peaks are retained for each range bin. The procedure stops earlier when no spectral component with power greater than the estimated noise level remains in the current Doppler window.

For the first range bin, no previous information is available. Therefore, the most prominent spectral component is initially selected and its radial velocity is used as the mean Doppler velocity. The Doppler window for the next range bin is then centered around the candidate whose radial velocity is closest to the previous mean Doppler velocity. This process is repeated sequentially with increasing range.

The adaptive-window procedure is represented in Figure 2.4

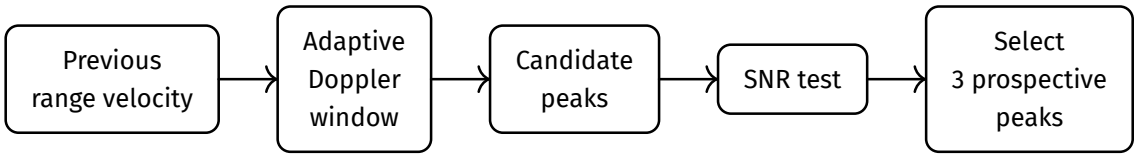


Figure 2.4: IME Adaptive window procedure

The wind Doppler signal is generally not expected to change by more than 20% of the total coherent-filter bandwidth, and therefore the Doppler-window width is restricted to less than 20% of the complete Doppler-axis width.

Grouping and Cost-Function-Based Profile Tracing

In this step the algorithm constructs possible traces between adjacent range bins. A trace represents a possible Doppler velocity profile through height. Constructing all possible traces over the complete range would result in a large computational load; therefore, the spectra are divided into small groups containing at least three consecutive range bins. Candidate peaks within each group are then connected from one range bin to the next. For the first group, the initial value is the Doppler velocity of the most prominent peak, while subsequent groups use the velocity at the highest range bin of the preceding group as their initial value. Figure 2.5 shows all links in a group and M_j^r indicates the j th peak of the r th range bin.

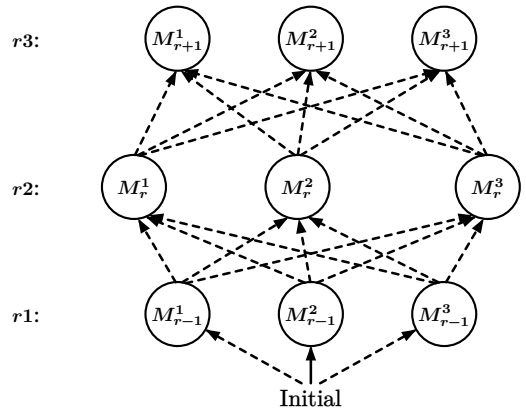


Figure 2.5: Grouping and profile tracing in IME. Each circle represents a candidate spectral peak

The cost assigned to a connection between two candidate peaks is based on two characteristics: the continuity of wind shear and the relative SNR of the candidate. The maximum allowable radial-velocity shear is determined by;

$$|\Delta v_{\mathrm{m}}| \leq 0.05 \sin(\theta) \Delta R \tag{2.1}$$

where Δv_{m} is the maximum radial-velocity shear, θ is the radar beam tilt angle, and ΔR is the range resolution.

To represent the continuity of the Doppler profile, a trapezoidal membership function is used:

$$T(x) = \begin{cases} 1 & |x| \leq \Delta v_{\mathrm{m}} \\ (2\Delta v_{\mathrm{m}} - |x|)/\Delta v_{\mathrm{m}} & \Delta v_{\mathrm{m}} < |x| < 2\Delta v_{\mathrm{m}} \\ 0 & |x| \geq 2\Delta v_{\mathrm{m}} \end{cases} \tag{2.2}$$

Here, x represents the wind-shear difference between two connected candidate peaks. A high membership value indicates that the change in velocity between adjacent range bins is consistent with the expected continuity of the atmospheric wind profile.

The relative SNR of a candidate peak is normalized with respect to the largest candidate SNR in the same range bin:

$$P_{r,j} = \frac{\alpha_{r,j}}{\max(\alpha_r)} \tag{2.3}$$

where $\alpha_{r,j}$ denotes the SNR of the j-th candidate peak in the r-th range bin. The complete link cost is then formed by combining the continuity term and the normalized SNR term:

$$C = w_1 T + w_2 P, \quad w_1 + w_2 = 1. \tag{2.4}$$

The weights determine the relative importance of wind-profile continuity and spectral strength. Based on experiments the selected values are,

$$w_1 = 0.4, \quad w_2 = 0.6.$$

Thus, the IME algorithm gives greater weight to the normalized SNR while still enforcing continuity between adjacent range bins. The total cost of each possible trace is calculated, and the trace with the largest total cost is selected as the final Doppler velocity profile for the corresponding group. The velocity at the highest range bin in the selected group then becomes the initial value for the next group.

Thus, Figure 2.6 illustrates how IME narrows the peak-search region and identifies a more consistent atmospheric Doppler profile.

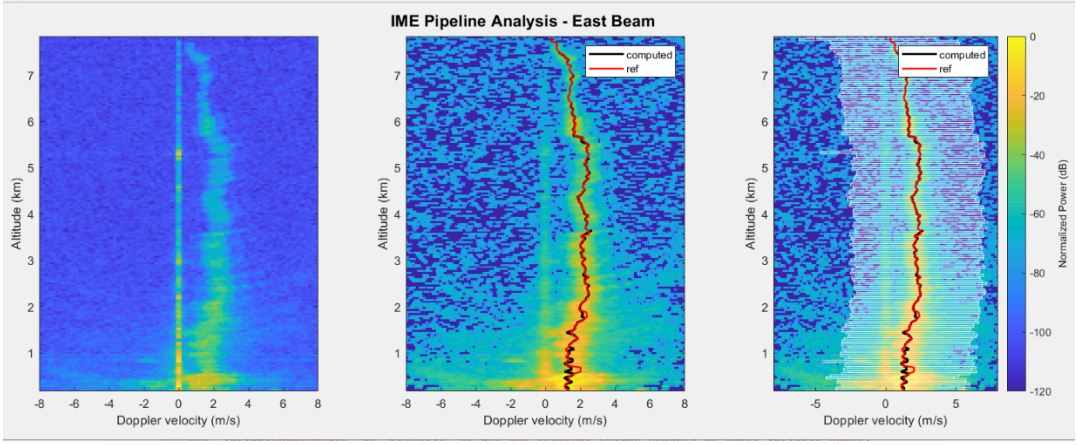


Figure 2.6: Doppler beam spectra a) Original b) after IME processing, c) Adaptive Doppler-window selection.

2.1.4 Hybrid Methods

The 2 algorithms discussed have several individual working components – computing spectrum, denoising, estimating peaks/moments, etc. The mutual convolution process in MCCF appears to suppress noise very effectively. In this light, we tried a method that combines both of these methods.

To make such mixing easier, our main focus was to first create a software architecture in MATLAB that encapsulates each of these components and provides a common interface. Then the individual components can be cascaded easily. Figure 2.7 Shows the method in which Mutual Convolution (MC) from MCCF is first used to determine the spectrum, and then later processing is done by IME itself.

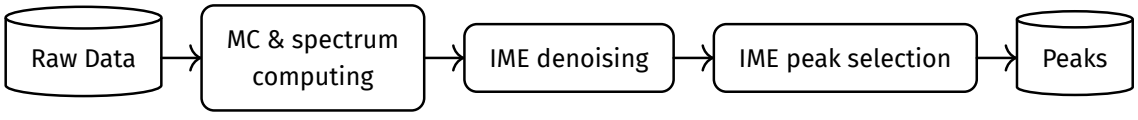


Figure 2.7: Flow of Hybrid-1 method

Figure 2.8 shows another method in which we eliminated denoising part of IME (since MC already performs some amount of denoising, we suspect that further denoising eliminates candidate peaks in low SNR regions)

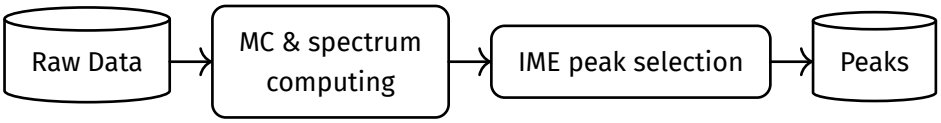


Figure 2.8: Flow of Hybrid-2 method

In practice, the parts of MCCF work iteratively in each height bin, taking feedback from previous bin, setting ST window appropriately, then selecting the best solution from MC that contains a peak falling in the ST window. For this mixing purpose, we took the MC part alone and let it run without the feedback.

2.2 Verification methods

To verify the algorithms we need a reliable ground truth to compare against the output of the algorithm. Below are few methods generally used in literature.

2.2.1 Radiosonde

A radiosonde is a battery-powered telemetry instrument carried into the atmosphere usually by a weather balloon that measures various atmospheric parameters and transmits them by radio to a ground receiver. Modern radiosondes measure or calculate the following variables: altitude, pressure, temperature, relative humidity, wind (both speed and direction), and some are also capable of cosmic ray readings at high altitude.



Figure 2.9: Radiosonde attached to weather balloon

The radiosonde reaches an altitude of 20 km to 30 km; thereafter, due to the low density of the atmosphere, the balloon explodes, and it falls down. The altitude reached in various radiosonde experiments is plotted in Figure 2.10 data = data[::30]

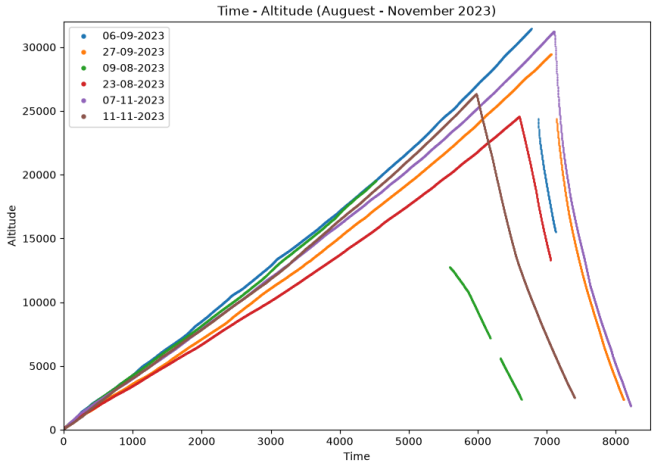


Figure 2.10: Altitude reached by various radiosonde.

In order for the data from the radiosonde to be useful for evaluating the algorithm, the balloon must hover over the same geographic area throughout the desired height range. For perspective, the ST radar has a beamwidth of 3°, Considering 30km target height, ideally, the ballon should be within $\tan(3°/2) \times 30 \text{ km} \approx 1 \text{ km}$ radius within the launch site. But this can be much higher, considering that the atmosphere can be slowly varying in certain seasons. However, the radiosondes often drift too far from their initial destinations. This is illustrated in Figure 2.12 and Figure 2.11. Data collected in the summer season is used for testing the algorithm. However, in those seasons, wind velocities are not turbulent enough to rigorously test the algorithm.

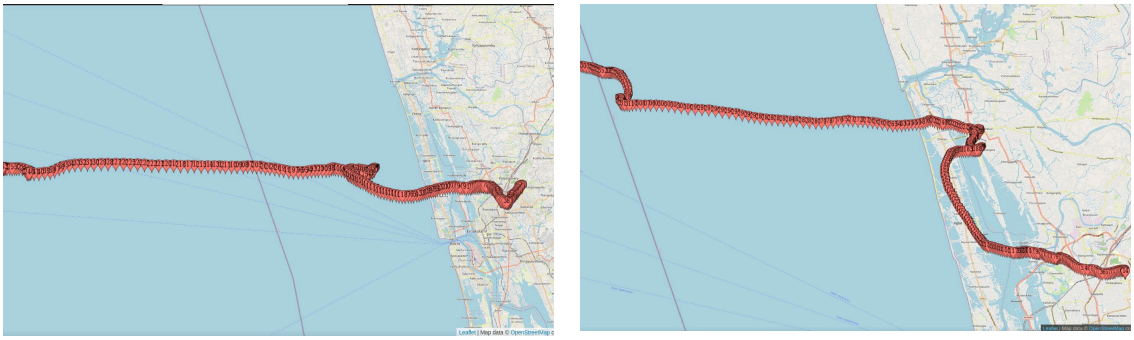


Figure 2.11: Trajectory of Radiosonde in the month of November 2023



Figure 2.12: Trajectory of Radiosonde in the month of February 2021

Moreover radiosondes are rarely launched at intervals of less than 6 hours and so can only be used to provide information about the large-scale weather patterns.

2.2.2 LIDAR

Light Detection and Ranging (LIDAR) is a method for determining ranges by targeting an object or a surface with a laser and measuring the time for the reflected light to return to the optical receiver. Lidar may operate in a fixed direction (e.g., vertical), or it may scan directions, in a special combination of 3D scanning and laser scanning. In [2] and [3], the researchers used a ground-based lidar for measuring the wind velocity of the lower atmosphere (up to 1 km). In [2], it is mentioned that the lidar can achieve 99% accuracy in clear atmospheric conditions. Hence, lidar serves as an excellent ground reference for evaluating the algorithm's performance.



Figure 2.13: A Lidar mounted on the rooftop of a building

2.2.3 Synthetic Data and Validation

Synthetic radar data are artificially generated radar observation data made from a predefined array of wind velocities. This is done by starting with a UVW array and reversing the process of a typical radar signal processing pipeline, starting from UVW estimation to writing a raw file onto disk. The primary advantage of this method is that we have a ground truth to compare the algorithm's output as well as control to create

data that can test the algorithms in various ways, which otherwise would require waiting to get suitable outputs from radar and manually going through them to pick a good one.

Background

While the algorithms are being developed, it is important to measure their performance with some metric. And to validate the algorithm, a ground truth is required. Traditionally, the default output of the radar signal processing chain implemented by Data Patterns was used. This approach has some drawbacks: first, the original algorithm may fail under certain breaking conditions (poor SNR, wind discontinuity, heavy interference, etc.), so it yields no useful data points in those height bins. Second, to test the algorithm under certain weather conditions, one must collect real-world observations, which may or may not be catalogued by weather patterns. Hence, for large-scale analysis of algorithms, reliance on physical data might not be viable. From this, we propose an idea of synthesising radar data on our own according to the specific needs.

Method of synthesis

The synthesiser is a reverse process of the radar processing chain shown in Figure 1.2. First, a UVW array is synthesised based on the needs of atmospheric conditions. It is generated by combining wind velocities generated by various types of winds and atmospheric phenomena. Currently, we took 8 different processes as shown in Figure 2.14. Then velocities are projected onto each beam direction; velocities are converted to a Doppler spectrum with spectrum broadening using [4] and Zrnić's method [5]. Additional clutters like ground and bright bands are added to the final spectrum.

The resulting spectrum is converted to the time domain. To create a radar raw file, a dummy header file that has a pattern similar to that found in actual radar is created, and this time series data is attached to it. The synthesised file is opened again with the same radar processing chain to test its validity. One sample of synthesised raw data is shown in Figure 2.15. The plot also compares the actual wind velocity with the output of the MCCF function. One important detail to note here is that not all components represent the actual physical processes. For eg, the synoptic background profile uses a basic model of wind velocity gradient due to surface friction. We used AI to figure out an initial list of wind components. However, our goal was to get a reasonably continuous, smooth pseudorandom wind profile and not to simulate the atmosphere as realistically as possible.

We created a testbench that generates 500 raw data samples, each containing beams in 5 directions. For each data sample, 5 different algorithms were applied; their MSE and correlation coefficient was computed, stored in a file and then processed it later. The results are shown in the results chapter.

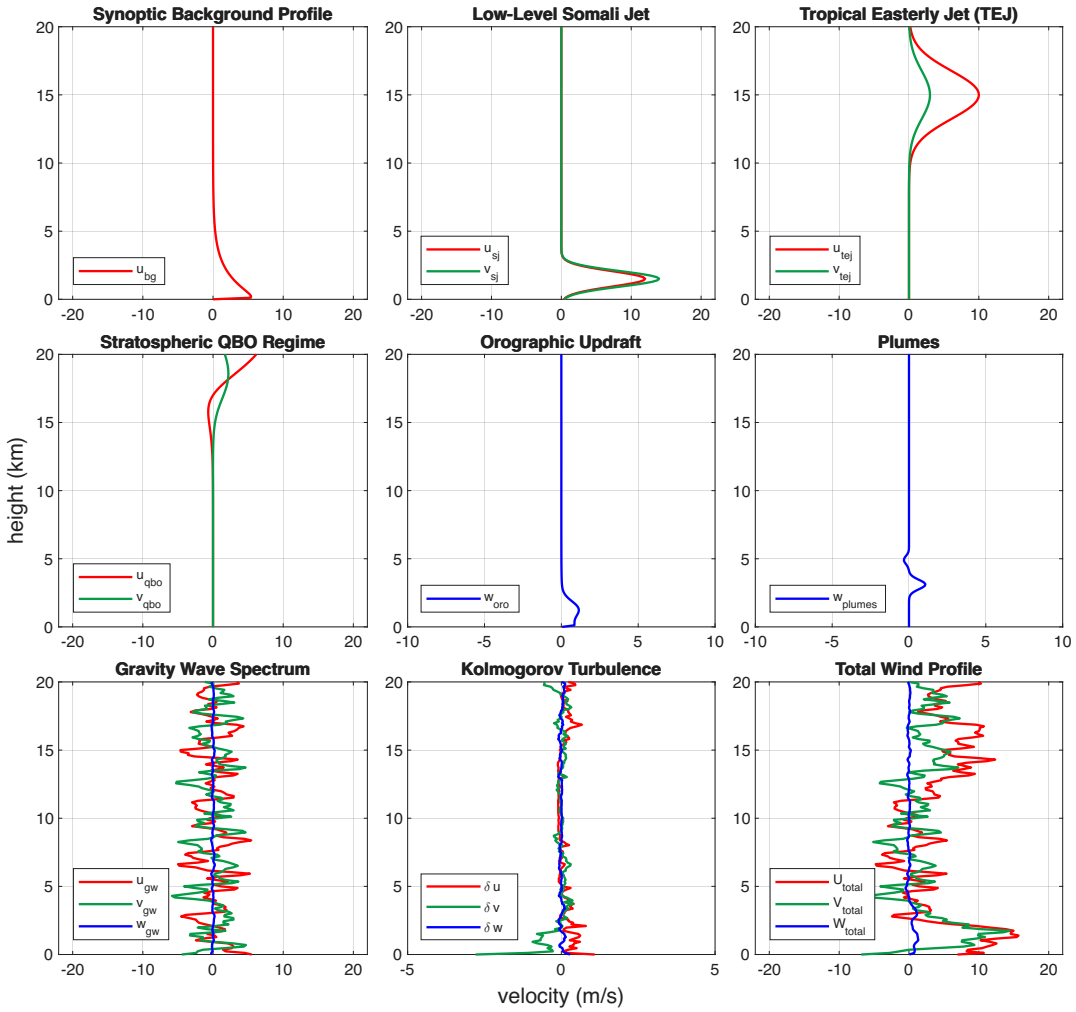


Figure 2.14: Various wind types and weather phenomena used in generating UVW array

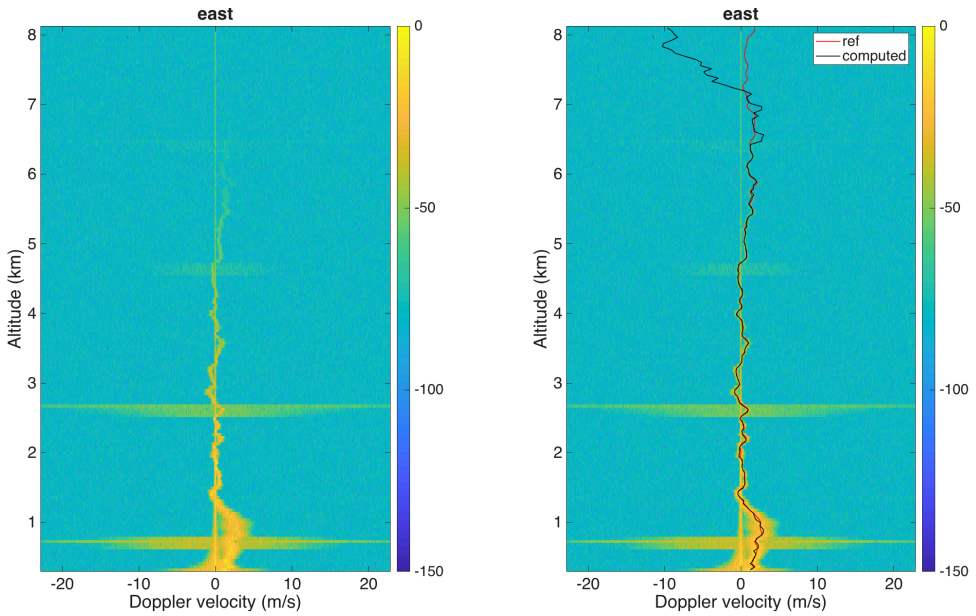


Figure 2.15: Synthesised raw data and corresponding velocity estimation using MCCF

Chapter 3:
Results

To test the accuracy of methods, many metrics can be used, such as latency, computational efficiency, accuracy, etc. For ST radar, which completes a full observation across 5 beams every 80 seconds for wind profiling, the first two seem irrelevant. Hence, to measure accuracy, we have used Mean Square Error (MSE) and Pearson's linear correlation [6]. Here we present validation with synthetic data and real data

3.1 Validation with synthetic data

In this method of evaluation, 500 raw data points were synthesised. Each of which was produced from the UVW array synthesised using randomised parameters. Additionally, ground clutter and bright bands at random altitudes were added to spectrum. The mean MSE in each of beams are shown in Figure 3.1. The distribution of MSE is summarized in Figure 3.2. Table 3.1 shows exact values.

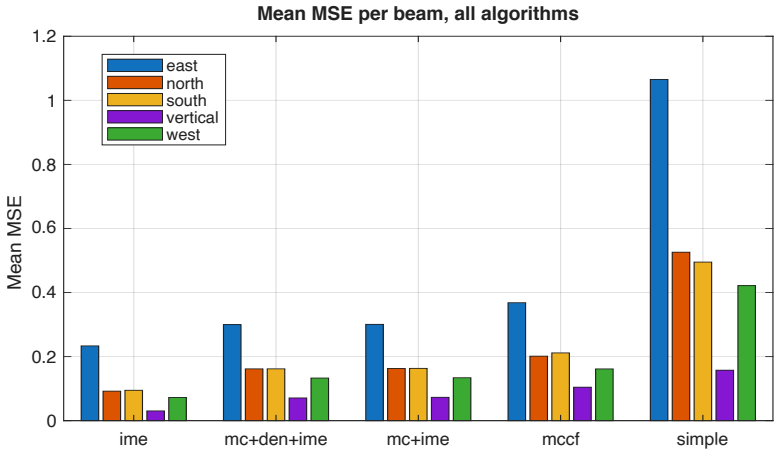


Figure 3.1: Comparison of mean MSE value of various algorithms in simulation runs

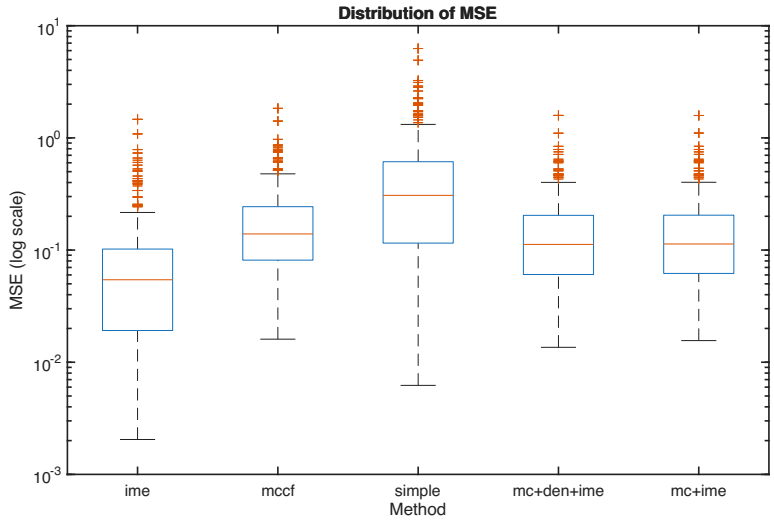


Figure 3.2: Comparison of distribution MSE in various algorithms in simulation runs

	IME	MC+DN+IME	MC+IME	MCCF	Simple
East	0.233	0.299	0.300	0.368	1.065
North	0.092	0.161	0.162	0.201	0.525
South	0.094	0.161	0.163	0.211	0.495
Vertical	0.030	0.071	0.073	0.104	0.157
West	0.072	0.133	0.134	0.161	0.421

Table 3.1: Mean Square error produced in each beams in simulation run

From Figure 3.1, it is clear that IME has better accuracy amongst all methods. The least error in the vertical direction is expected because in that direction, wind velocity is close to zero most of the time. However, the high error in the east beam is unexpected, and we couldn't trace any specific cause for it. From Figure 3.2, the distribution of MSE is much more spread out in the simple method. The hybrid method shows no difference and is suboptimal compared to IME, indicating that the combination of IME and mutual convolution is inefficient compared to IME alone.

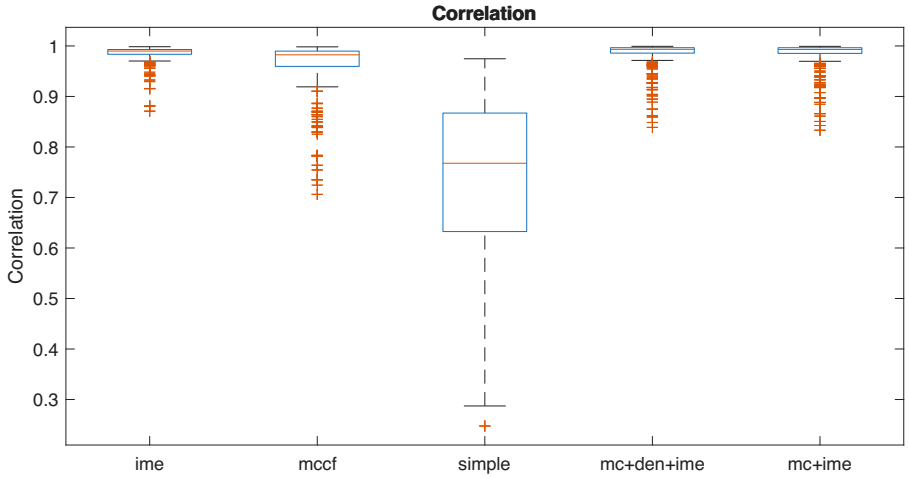


Figure 3.3: Distribution of correlation between reference and computed value in simulated data

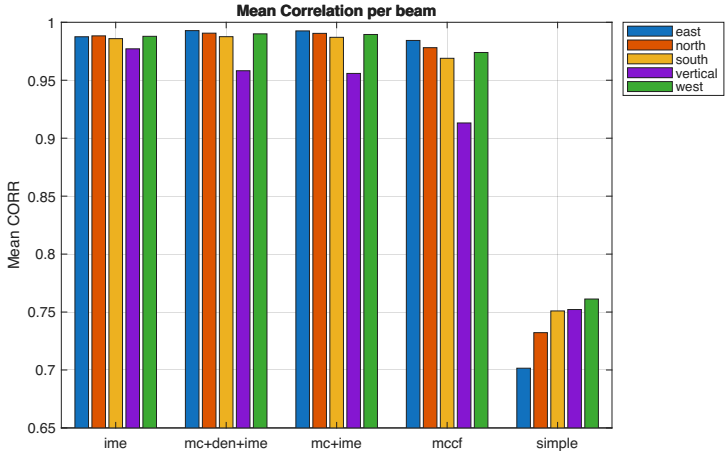


Figure 3.4: Correlation in each beam in simulated data

	IME	MC+DN+IME	MC+IME	MCCM	Simple
East	0.987	0.992	0.992	0.984	0.701
North	0.988	0.990	0.990	0.978	0.732
South	0.985	0.987	0.987	0.968	0.750
Vertical	0.977	0.958	0.955	0.913	0.752
West	0.987	0.990	0.989	0.973	0.761

Table 3.2: Table of correlation values

The correlation among computed wind velocity and reference is plotted in Figure 3.3 and Figure 3.4, the exact values are given in Table 3.2. The correlation turns out to be a poor measure compared to MSE. This is partly due to the scale invariance of the correlation function. However, the correlation is used in the literature. Hence, we decided to include it in this report. Paradoxically, here, the east beam has the highest correlation among all beams (except in simple algorithms). The difference is minute, which can result from slight numerical error in the computation flow.

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Appendix

A.1 Source code

MATLAB implementation of algorithm are available in
https://github.com/roopeshor/Radar-Signal-Processing